

Explaining the Relative Nature of General and Special Relativity

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ABSTRACT: In this paper, we show that time dilation is not a property of a single system but a comparison between two systems, defined solely by their relative spatial distribution of mass. Specifically stated, the time dilation between two systems is governed by the relative DeGerlia Inertial Density D , defined as mass divided by mean radius about the compared axis. We first exemplify this comparative nature with one of the most fundamental equivalences in General Relativity, the gravitational time-dilation equation, which computes a system's time dilation relative to flat space-time: $d\tau/dt = \sqrt{1 - r_s/r}$. We use this reference value to validate the calculation we perform using relative D alone. We then validate correct calculations for a diverse set of two-system examples, including transformed systems (similar to the gravitational time dilation above, where system 2 is a transformed version of system 1) as well as discrete system comparisons, across the classical and relativistic regimes. To conduct this demonstration, we introduce the DeGerlia Time Dilation Framework (DTDF), a simple, mathematically equivalent framework, fully defined by general relativity, that offers a second frame for visualizing the relative nature of time.

Keywords: time dilation, general relativity, special relativity, gravitational time dilation, Lorentz time dilation, DeGerlia inertial density, inertial density, moment of inertia, astrophysics, Schwarzschild radius, DTDF, DTD, degerlia time dilation

1 Introduction

General Relativity¹ is a model for describing our universe that is fundamentally comparative: no quantity has physical meaning without a comparator. The pace of time is no exception: the time dilation between two systems is a product of the systems' relative geometric mass distributions. Directly from the gravitational time dilation (GTD) formula, one can derive the underlying two-system logic, and ultimately, GTD is simply a comparison between a system's pace of time relative to the pace of time of a selected benchmark system, which in this case is a system of the same mass, but at its Schwarzschild radius. The formula requires only one mass and one radius, the second system being derived

directly from the first. While this is the familiar representation, it obscures the comparative nature of relativity and implies that one need not compare two systems to characterize time. That implication is incorrect: there is no privileged perspective from which to characterize time. In this paper, we evaluate the physical property responsible for relativistic time dilation and explore the underlying formulation that quantifies the relative time dilation between two systems.

The relative flow of time between two systems is governed solely by their relative DeGerlia inertial density D . We demonstrate this across a range of uniform spherical systems, from the classical to the relativistic regime, by calculating each system's DeGerlia time dilation from its relative D , converting each to its gravitational time dilation, and taking their ratio. In each case this matches the ratio obtained by computing each system's gravitational time dilation independently from the standard Schwarzschild form, to the precision permitted by G . Given two

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Table 1 System properties for each pair comparison case.

Property	Case 1 $m = m_s \sim r_s$	Case 2 $m = m_s \sim \frac{4}{3}r_s$	Case 3 $r = r$	Case 4 $\rho = \rho$	Case 5 Classical	Case 6 $l = l$	Case 7 General
m_1 (kg)	2.00000e+30	1.00000e+30	1.00000e+30	1.00000e+30	8.00000e+0	1.00000e+32	1.00000e+20
m_2 (kg)	2.00000e+30	1.00000e+30	1.00000e+24	1.00000e+27	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+30	1.00000e+30
r_1 (m)	2.97049e+3	1.98031e+3	1.00000e+8	1.00000e+8	2.00000e+0	1.00000e+7	2.00000e-7
r_2 (m)	7.00000e+8	1.00000e+8	1.00000e+8	1.00000e+7	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+8	1.00000e+7
ρ_1 (kg/m ³)	1.82161e+19	3.07406e+19	2.38732e+5	2.38732e+5	2.38732e-1	2.38732e+10	2.98416e+39
ρ_2 (kg/m ³)	1.39203e+3	2.38732e+5	2.38732e-1	2.38732e+5	2.38732e-1	2.38732e+5	2.38732e+8
I_1 (kg·m ²)	7.05907e+36	1.56865e+36	4.00000e+45	4.00000e+45	1.28000e+1	4.00000e+45	1.60000e+6
I_2 (kg·m ²)	3.92000e+47	4.00000e+45	4.00000e+39	4.00000e+40	4.00000e-1	4.00000e+45	4.00000e+43
D_1 (kg/m)	6.73289e+26	5.04972e+26	1.00000e+22	1.00000e+22	4.00000e+0	1.00000e+25	5.00000e+26
D_2 (kg/m)	2.85714e+21	1.00000e+22	1.00000e+16	1.00000e+20	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+22	1.00000e+23
r_{s1} (m)	2.97046e+3	1.48523e+3	1.48523e+3	1.48523e+3	1.18819e-26	1.48523e+5	1.48523e-7
r_{s2} (m)	2.97046e+3	1.48523e+3	1.48523e-3	1.48523e+0	1.48523e-27	1.48523e+3	1.48523e+3
$D_{\text{norm},1}$	9.99991e-1	7.50001e-1	1.48523e-5	1.48523e-5	5.94093e-27	1.48523e-2	7.42617e-1
$D_{\text{norm},2}$	4.24352e-6	1.48523e-5	1.48523e-11	1.48523e-7	1.48523e-27	1.48523e-5	1.48523e-4
k_s	9.99990e-1	7.50000e-1	1.48523e-5	1.48523e-5	5.94093e-27	1.48523e-2	7.42616e-1
k_d	9.99991e-1	7.50001e-1	1.48523e-5	1.48523e-5	5.94093e-27	1.48523e-2	7.42617e-1
GTD _{s1}	1-9.96838e-1	1-5.00000e-1	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.42619e-6	1-2.97046e-27	1-7.45394e-3	1-4.92670e-1
GTD _{s2}	1-2.12176e-6	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.42616e-12	1-7.42616e-8	1-7.42616e-28	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.42644e-5
GTD _{d1}	1-9.96948e-1	1-5.00001e-1	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.42619e-6	1-2.97047e-27	1-7.45395e-3	1-4.92670e-1
GTD _{d2}	1-2.12176e-6	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.42617e-12	1-7.42617e-8	1-7.42617e-28	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.42644e-5
DTD ₁	9.99995e-1	8.66026e-1	3.85387e-3	3.85387e-3	7.70774e-14	1.21870e-1	8.61752e-1
DTD ₂	2.05998e-3	3.85387e-3	3.85387e-6	3.85387e-4	3.85387e-14	3.85387e-3	1.21870e-2

Table 2 Derived ratios across cases.

Ratio	Case 1 $m = m_s \sim r_s$	Case 2 $m = m_s \sim \frac{4}{3}r_s$	Case 3 $r = r$	Case 4 $\rho = \rho$	Case 5 Classical	Case 6 $l = l$	Case 7 General
DTD ₁ /DTD ₂	4.85439e+2	2.24716e+2	1.00000e+3	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	3.16228e+1	7.07107e+1
$\sqrt{D_1/D_2}$	4.85439e+2	2.24716e+2	1.00000e+3	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	3.16228e+1	7.07107e+1
$\sqrt{(m_1 r_2)/(m_2 r_1)}$	4.85439e+2	2.24716e+2	1.00000e+3	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	3.16228e+1	7.07107e+1
$\sqrt{(I_1/I_2)(r_2/r_1)^3}$	4.85439e+2	2.24716e+2	1.00000e+3	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	3.16228e+1	7.07107e+1
$(I_1/I_2)^{1/5}(\rho_1/\rho_2)^{3/10}$	4.85439e+2	2.24716e+2	1.00000e+3	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	3.16228e+1	7.07107e+1
$(m_1 r_2)/(m_2 r_1)$	2.35651e+5	5.04972e+4	1.00000e+6	1.00000e+2	4.00000e+0	1.00000e+3	5.00000e+3
D_1/D_2	2.35651e+5	5.04972e+4	1.00000e+6	1.00000e+2	4.00000e+0	1.00000e+3	5.00000e+3
$(I_1/I_2)(r_2/r_1)^3$	2.35651e+5	5.04972e+4	1.00000e+6	1.00000e+2	4.00000e+0	1.00000e+3	5.00000e+3
GTD _{s1} /GTD _{s2}	1-9.96838e-1	1-4.99996e-1	1-7.42618e-6	1-7.35193e-6	1-2.22785e-27	1-7.44657e-3	1-4.92632e-1
GTD _{d1} /GTD _{d2}	1-9.96948e-1	1-4.99997e-1	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.35193e-6	1-2.22785e-27	1-7.44658e-3	1-4.92633e-1
$\sqrt{1 - \text{DTD}_1^2}/\sqrt{1 - \text{DTD}_2^2}$	1-9.96948e-1	1-4.99997e-1	1-7.42619e-6	1-7.35193e-6	1-2.22785e-27	1-7.44658e-3	1-4.92633e-1
I_1/I_2	1.80078e-11	3.92163e-10	1.00000e+6	1.00000e+5	3.20000e+1	1.00000e+0	4.00000e-38
$(I_1/I_2)^{1/2}$	4.24356e-6	1.98031e-5	1.00000e+3	3.16228e+2	5.65685e+0	1.00000e+0	2.00000e-19
$(\rho_1/\rho_2)^{1/5}(r_1/r_2)$	7.09728e-3	1.31430e-2	1.58489e+1	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	1.00000e+0	3.31445e-8
$(I_1/I_2)^{1/5}$	7.09728e-3	1.31430e-2	1.58489e+1	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	1.00000e+0	3.31445e-8
m_1/m_2	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+6	1.00000e+3	8.00000e+0	1.00000e+2	1.00000e-10
$\sqrt{m_1/m_2}$	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+3	3.16228e+1	2.82843e+0	1.00000e+1	1.00000e-5
r_1/r_2	4.24356e-6	1.98031e-5	1.00000e+0	1.00000e+1	2.00000e+0	1.00000e-1	2.00000e-14
$\sqrt{r_1/r_2}$	2.05999e-3	4.45007e-3	1.00000e+0	3.16228e+0	1.41421e+0	3.16228e-1	1.41421e-7

systems' masses and radii, their relative time dilation is determined by their relative spatial distribution of mass alone — a relation already contained in general relativity.

2 Experimental Model

The experimental model employed in this study comprises several components. The framework is derived directly from general relativity and is mathematically equivalent to established general-relativistic calculations. It neither relies upon nor introduces any principle not already established within the theories of general and special relativity; this paper leverages a framing of the existing theory of relativity for illustrative purposes.

We begin by introducing the DeGerlia Framework and then demonstrate its complete mathematical equivalence with general relativity. We then work through a series of examples, each demonstrating a different comparative case, and in each case, we validate the result using standard gravitational time-dilation calculations.

These examples demonstrate the two-system nature of all relativistic calculations. Relativity is fundamentally concerned with how quantities appear relative to one another; gravitational time dilation, for instance, reflects the comparison of a system with an identical system at its Schwarzschild radius, the collapse-condition radius r_s .

3 The DeGerlia Time Dilation Framework

3.1 Definitions, Formulas and Constants Used Herein

Symbol	Definition / Value
c	Light Speed $299\,792\,458\,\text{m s}^{-1}$
D	DeGerlia Inertial Density m/r , where r is the mean radius about a selected axis
D_{crit}	DeGerlia Threshold $c^2/2G = 6.73295\text{e}26\,\text{kg/m}$
DTD	DeGerlia Time Dilation $\sqrt{k}$
G	Gravitational Constant $6.67430\text{e}-11 \pm 1.5\text{e}-15\,\text{m}^3\,\text{kg}^{-1}\,\text{s}^{-2}$
GTD	Gravitational Time Dilation $d\tau/dt = \sqrt{1-k}$
k	Linear Scale Factor $v^2/c^2 = r_s/r = D/D_{\text{crit}}$
k_D	Linear Scale Factor (DeGerlia inertial density) D/D_{crit}
k_s	Linear Scale Factor (Schwarzschild) r_s/r
k_v	Linear Scale Factor (velocity) v^2/c^2
P	Inertial Density $I/V = D \cdot 3/10\pi$
r_s	Schwarzschild Radius $2Gm/c^2$

3.2 What is the DeGerlia Time Dilation Framework?

First and foremost, the entirety of the principles described herein represents no deviation from general relativity. It represents a mathematically equivalent reframing useful in certain relativistic calculations. The author has simply asserted a complement to GTD, where the form of time dilation is equal to $\sqrt{k}$, instead of $\sqrt{1-k}$.

While equivalent to GTD mathematically, the DTD form offers a different perspective on the same physical phenomenon. It is a complementary perspective that aids in visualizing the underlying

physics:

- One can convert between GTD and DTD at any time. GTD is always recoverable.
- DTD is mathematically very easy to use and visualize, requiring only the ratio of mass to radius in comparison to a static constant to perform gravitational time dilation calculations.
- DTD allows for direct calculation of time dilation between two systems, without the need to reference a third system (the Schwarzschild condition)
- DTD returns finite output over the entire range of finite input.
- DTD represents flat spacetime as an ideal state that can only be approached.
- DTD represents the Schwarzschild condition as the point where the gravitational escape velocity exceeds the speed of light, and an event horizon forms. While we have observed black holes, the asymptotically approached ideal state of zero time dilation is not attainable.
- DTD reflects the singularity state as an asymptotic approach to $r = 0$.

3.3 Inertia and Moment of Inertia

In classical physics, inertia dictates how a system's motion changes in response to an applied force. This applies to both linear and rotational motion. In rotational dynamics, the "moment of inertia"² I dictates how the angular motion of a system about a specific axis changes when a torque is applied, and is defined as the sum of each mass element multiplied by the square of its distance from the axis of rotation.

$$\text{Moment of Inertia: } I = \sum_i m_i r_i^2 \quad (1)$$

Using Equation (1), one can determine how a system's motion changes when energy is applied about an axis (torque). As it pertains to linear motion, inertia (I) is characterized solely by the system's mass.

Inertia and moment of inertia have several notable properties.

1. Inertia is dimensional: it exists in, and has a component within, each of the three spatial dimensions.
2. Inertia is multimodal: it may be linear or rotational. Linear inertia reflects the mass alone, whereas rotational inertia reflects the mass times the square of its radius about an axis.
3. The moment of inertia is additive about a given axis: if a system is divided into parts and each part's moment of inertia is measured about that same axis, the total is unchanged.
4. Inertia relates force to motion: it determines the change in motion produced by an applied force or torque, making it the bridge between the two. Lower inertia yields greater motion for a given force.

3.4 General Relativity and Time Dilation

General Relativity provides the formula for calculating a system's time dilation relative to "flat space-time".

$$d\tau/dt = \sqrt{1-k} \quad (2)$$

where $k = r_s/r = 2Gm/(rc^2)$, m is the system's mass, and r its radius.

The equation requires only a single system's mass and radius, yet k is itself a ratio of two radii: the system's radius r and the Schwarzschild radius r_s (11) of that same mass. The calculation is therefore a comparison of two systems: the system as given, and the same mass at its Schwarzschild radius.

3.5 Definition of a System

A "system" is defined as any discrete collection of particles and the space between them, or equivalently, any unit of space and the particles contained within it. The framework regards the universe not as a clean separation of discrete material systems separated by the vacuum of space, but as a gradient of material density pervasive throughout. The most extreme densities reside not within near-scale systems but within the cores of highly dense gravitational objects far from the human scale, such as black holes or subatomic particles, and form a gradient extending to the near-scale "vacuum of space" at which another gravitational source begins to dominate. The framework imposes no requirement for uniformity or symmetry, a clean boundary separating matter from vacuum, or any particular density profile. It requires only a mass and a radius about a chosen axis. A system may be specified, for example, as the Earth out to the mean radius of its surface. For a body such as Jupiter, which lacks a clear boundary separating surface from atmosphere, the system may instead be specified out to a chosen radius or density. For a large system, a spherical sample may be taken from within it to characterize the behavior of particular regions. There can be no system modeled under General Relativity that lacks either mass or radius.

3.6 System Time

For a whole system (as distinct from any subsystem), and from that whole system's perspective, the pace of time is static and all other systems are perceived relative to that benchmark. A subsystem possesses distinct physical properties and consequently exhibits behavior different from that of the system as a whole. In general relativity, time dilation scales precisely with the relative mass-to-radius ratio; a part of a system, therefore, cannot be expected to share the pace of time of the whole.

3.7 Inertial Density P

Inertial density P as shown in (4) is a fundamental system property³ characterizing the distribution of inertia across any system, whether in the linear or rotational context, in any direction, or about any axis. If we were to redefine classical density as I/V (inertia/volume), because inertia is mass for one-dimensional motion, this would remain consistent with the classical definition of density, where $\rho = m/V$.

Inertial density characterizes how a system's mass is distributed relative to its axis, for a given mass and volume. Consider the configuration with the greatest moment of inertia for a given volume: a thin shell, in which all mass resides at the radius, displaced as far from the axis as the geometry permits. A soap bubble exemplifies this configuration; per unit volume it possesses substantial inertia despite its low mass, representing the maximum-inertia structure for its volume. Conversely, a configuration of equal radius with its mass concentrated as an approximate point mass at the center represents the opposite limit: as the mass concentrates toward the center, the moment of inertia approaches zero. The uniform solid sphere lies between these limits. What determines the inertia about a given axis is the mean radius of the mass distribution about that axis; the internal density gradient that produces a given mean radius does not enter, just as ordinary density averages over a system's internal structure and the density of any subset is obtained by evaluating that subset directly.

3.8 Mathematics of Inertial Density

To derive the inertial density relationship, we begin with the established relationship between mass and density ρ as shown in (3):

$$\rho = \frac{m}{V} \quad (3)$$

where ρ is density, m is mass, and V is volume. Because mass is equivalent to linear inertia, and because density is m/V , we define inertial density P in terms of moment of inertia over volume:

$$\text{Inertial Density : } P = \frac{I}{V} \quad (4)$$

where inertial density P is equal to inertia I over volume V . Note, the moment of inertia I for a system may be distinct about every axis for systems that are not uniform⁴. For a uniform sphere⁵, we substitute $I = \frac{2}{5}mr^2$ and $V = \frac{4}{3}\pi r^3$:

$$P = \frac{I}{V} = \frac{\frac{2}{5}mr^2}{\frac{4}{3}\pi r^3} = \frac{3m}{10\pi r} \quad (5)$$

Which can be simplified as follows:

$$P = \frac{m}{r} \times \frac{3}{10\pi} \quad (6)$$

$$P = \frac{m}{r} \times 9.549296585e-2 \quad (7)$$

Therefore, for spherical systems, P can be calculated as the ratio of mass to radius, multiplied by the conversion factor $\frac{3}{10\pi}$ as shown in (7).

3.9 DeGerlia Inertial Density D

For all spherical systems, m/r multiplied by the geometric factor $3/(10\pi)$ yields the inertial density. *DeGerlia inertial density* is a simplified analog of inertial density I/V , equal to the mass-to-radius ratio m/r with the $3/(10\pi)$ geometric conversion factor

omitted:

$$\text{DeGerlia Inertial Density: } D = \frac{m}{r} \quad (8)$$

DeGerlia inertial density (8) $D = m/r$ is related to inertial density P by the geometric factor $3/10\pi$ as shown in (9):

$$P = \frac{3}{10\pi} \times D \quad (9)$$

In a linear context, inertia is mass, and inertial density reduces directly to mass density $\rho = m/V$. From this perspective, inertial density is the rotational analog of mass density, paralleling the relationship between $F = ma$ and $\tau = I\alpha$. Equivalently, mass density is the linear interpretation of inertial density.

Just as ordinary density ($\rho = m/V$) is linear inertia (mass) distributed over volume, DeGerlia inertial density is rotational inertia distributed over volume. As stated in the prior work, *mass and density are to linear motion as moment of inertia and inertial density are to rotational motion*.

Because D is almost always used in a ratio that cancels all geometric constants, this metric is typically preferred over the geometrically accurate inertial density P for ease of use.

3.10 DeGerlia Threshold D_{crit}

The Schwarzschild condition can be expressed as a static universal constant threshold of DeGerlia inertial density D , rather than as a value that must be recalculated for every mass.

Setting $r = r_s$ (the Schwarzschild condition), the DeGerlia inertial density D becomes the threshold D_{crit} :

$$D_{\text{crit}} = \frac{m}{r_s} \quad (10)$$

Recall the Schwarzschild radius⁶:

$$r_s = \frac{2Gm}{c^2} \quad (11)$$

Substitute r_s into the expression for D_{crit} :

$$D_{\text{crit}} = \frac{m}{\frac{2Gm}{c^2}} = \frac{mc^2}{2Gm} = \frac{c^2}{2G} \quad (12)$$

Insert the fundamental constants⁷, $c = 2.99792458\text{e}8\text{ms}^{-1}$ and $G = 6.67430\text{e}-11\text{m}^3\text{kg}^{-1}\text{s}^{-2}$:

$$\begin{aligned} D_{\text{crit}} &= \frac{(2.99792458\text{e}8)^2}{2 \times 6.67430\text{e}-11} \text{kg/m} \\ &= \frac{8.98755179\text{e}16}{1.334860\text{e}-10} \\ &= 6.73295\text{e}26 \text{kg/m} \end{aligned}$$

$$\text{DeGerlia Threshold: } D_{\text{crit}} = 6.73295\text{e}26 \text{kg/m} \quad (13)$$

The DeGerlia Threshold (13) is the universal constant value of DeGerlia inertial density D at which the escape velocity equals the speed of light: the mass-over-radius threshold at which gravitational collapse (collapse of the neutron structure) occurs.

Note this value is limited by the precision of the gravitational constant⁸, $G = 6.67430\text{e}-11 \pm 1.5\text{e}-15\text{m}^3\text{kg}^{-1}\text{s}^{-2}$. Just as the Schwarzschild radius, the DeGerlia threshold is universally applicable to spherical gravitational systems; examples include black holes or neutron stars, a spherical region of an interstellar cloud, or even a galactic cluster.

Rapid evaluation of the black hole condition. For a single system, divide its mass by its radius and compare the result with the DeGerlia Threshold (13), $D_{\text{crit}} = 6.73295\text{e}26\text{kg/m}$. If their ratio equals 1, the system is at the black hole condition; if it is less than 1, no collapse has occurred.

3.11 DeGerlia Time Dilation

DeGerlia Time Dilation (DTD) (14) is the Pythagorean complement (15) of gravitational time dilation:

$$\text{GTD} = \sqrt{1-k}$$

$$\text{DTD} = \sqrt{k} \quad (14)$$

$$\text{GTD}^2 + \text{DTD}^2 = 1 \quad (15)$$

where k is the linear scale factor.

3.12 The Linear Scale Factor k

The linear scale factor k is a common element among all established forms of time dilation. Time dilation is always:

$$\frac{d\tau}{dt} = \sqrt{1-k}$$

where $d\tau/dt$ is the time-dilation factor between the two systems and k is the linear scale factor between the two systems. Specific forms of k follow:

- $k = r_s/r$, the standard Schwarzschild condition.
- $k = D/D_{\text{crit}} = (m/r)/(6.73295\text{e}26\text{kg/m})$, via the DeGerlia inertial density against its threshold.
- $k = v^2/c^2$, as used in special relativity.

4 Relative Time Dilation Examples

Tables 1 and 2 present the complete system properties and derived ratios for seven system pairs spanning the cases that follow: equal mass at the Schwarzschild radius, equal mass at four-thirds the Schwarzschild radius, equal radius, equal density, a classical case, equal moment of inertia, and a general unconstrained case.

Across every case, the time-dilation ratio computed via the DeGerlia inertial density ratio agrees with the gravitational time-dilation ratio computed independently from the standard Schwarzschild form, to the limit of precision imposed by G . No case requires a separate formula. The worked examples in the following subsections show the full calculations, case by case.

4.1 Case 1: ($m_1 = m_2$, $r_1 \approx r_s$)

The two identical masses cancel, reducing the DeGerlia inertial density ratio to a ratio of radii. Note that this reflects the k calculation for gravitational time dilation, where we compare with r_s . Because $GTD = 0$ exactly at r_s , we set the comparison radius to $1.00001 r_s$, an "arbitrarily" small amount above r_s .

System properties:

	System 1 (S_1)	System 2 (S_2)
m (kg)	2.00000e30	2.00000e30
r (m)	2.97049e3	7.00000e8

Calculate DTD for each System:

$$\begin{aligned}
 DTD &= \sqrt{k} \quad \text{where} \quad k = m/(rD_{\text{crit}}) \\
 k_1 &= \frac{2.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(2.97049e3 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 9.9999068441e-1 \\
 DTD_1 &= \sqrt{9.9999068441e-1} = 9.9999534220e-1 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{2.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(7.00000e8 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 4.24352e-6 \\
 DTD_2 &= \sqrt{4.24352e-6} = 2.05998e-3 \\
 \frac{DTD_1}{DTD_2} &= \frac{9.9999534220e-1}{2.05998e-3} = 4.85439e2
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate the GTD ratio from DTD:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= \frac{\sqrt{1 - DTD_1^2}}{\sqrt{1 - DTD_2^2}} = \frac{\sqrt{1 - (9.9999534220e-1)^2}}{\sqrt{1 - (2.05998e-3)^2}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{1 - 9.9999068441e-1}}{\sqrt{1 - 4.24352e-6}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{9.9999534220e-1}}{\sqrt{9.9999534220e-1}} \\
 &= \frac{3.05214e-3}{9.9999787824e-1} = 3.05215e-3 \\
 &= 1 - 9.9694785e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Verify by calculating the GTD from the Schwarzschild Radius Ratio:
Schwarzschild radii:

$$\begin{aligned}
 r_{s1} = r_{s2} &= \frac{2Gm}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(2.00000e30 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 2.97046e3 \text{ m}
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate k values from the r_s/r ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 k_1 &= \frac{r_{s1}}{r_1} = \frac{2.97046e3 \text{ m}}{2.97049e3 \text{ m}} = 9.999900010e-1 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{r_{s2}}{r_2} = \frac{2.97046e3 \text{ m}}{7.00000e8 \text{ m}} = 4.24352e-6
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate GTD via Schwarzschild radius ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 GTD_{s1} &= \sqrt{1 - k_1} = \sqrt{9.99990e-6} = 3.16226e-3 = 1 - 9.9683774e-1 \\
 GTD_{s2} &= \sqrt{1 - k_2} = \sqrt{9.9999575648e-1} = 9.9999787824e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 2.12176e-6 \\
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= \frac{3.16226e-3}{9.9999787824e-1} = 3.16227e-3 \\
 &= 1 - 9.9683773e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Time-dilation ratio between System 1 and System 2, computed two ways:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= 1 - 9.9683773e-1 \quad (\text{via } r_s) \\
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= 1 - 9.9694785e-1 \quad (\text{via } D_{\text{crit}})
 \end{aligned}$$

4.2 Case 2: ($m_1 = m_2$, $r_1 = \frac{4}{3}r_s$)

The two identical masses cancel, reducing the DeGerlia inertial density ratio to a ratio of radii. Note: This reflects the k calculation for gravitational time dilation. However, in this case, instead of comparing with r_s , we compare with $\frac{4}{3}r_s$, which corresponds to a gravitational time dilation of $GTD = 5.00000e-1$.

System properties:

	System 1 (S_1)	System 2 (S_2)
m (kg)	1.00000e30	1.00000e30
r (m)	1.98031e3	1.00000e8

Calculate DTD for each System:

$$\begin{aligned}
 DTD &= \sqrt{k} \quad \text{where} \quad k = m/(rD_{\text{crit}}) \\
 k_1 &= \frac{1.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(1.98031e3 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 7.50001e-1 \\
 DTD_1 &= \sqrt{7.50001e-1} = 8.66026e-1 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{1.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(1.00000e8 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 1.48523e-5 \\
 DTD_2 &= \sqrt{1.48523e-5} = 3.85387e-3 \\
 \frac{DTD_1}{DTD_2} &= \frac{8.66026e-1}{3.85387e-3} = 2.24716e2
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate the GTD ratio from DTD:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= \frac{\sqrt{1 - DTD_1^2}}{\sqrt{1 - DTD_2^2}} = \frac{\sqrt{1 - (8.66026e-1)^2}}{\sqrt{1 - (3.85387e-3)^2}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{1 - 7.50001e-1}}{\sqrt{1 - 1.48523e-5}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{2.49999e-1}}{\sqrt{9.999951477e-1}} \\
 &= \frac{4.99999e-1}{9.9999257381e-1} = 5.00003e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 4.99997e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Verify by calculating the GTD from the Schwarzschild Radius Ratio:
Schwarzschild radii:

$$\begin{aligned}
 r_{s1} = r_{s2} &= \frac{2Gm}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e30 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523e3 \text{ m}
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate k values from the r_s/r ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 k_1 &= \frac{r_{s1}}{r_1} = \frac{1.48523e3 \text{ m}}{1.98031e3 \text{ m}} = 7.50000e-1 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{r_{s2}}{r_2} = \frac{1.48523e3 \text{ m}}{1.00000e8 \text{ m}} = 1.48523e-5
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate GTD via Schwarzschild radius ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 GTD_{s1} &= \sqrt{1 - k_1} = \sqrt{2.50000e-1} = 5.00000e-1 = 1 - 5.00000e-1 \\
 GTD_{s2} &= \sqrt{1 - k_2} = \sqrt{9.999951477e-1} = 9.9999257381e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.42619e-6 \\
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= \frac{5.00000e-1}{9.9999257381e-1} = 5.00004e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 4.99996e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Time-dilation ratio between System 1 and System 2, computed two ways:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= 1 - 4.99996e-1 \quad (\text{via } r_s) \\
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= 1 - 4.99997e-1 \quad (\text{via } D_{\text{crit}})
 \end{aligned}$$

4.3 Case 3: ($r_1 = r_2$)

When the two systems share the same radius, the radius terms cancel. The Lorentz factor⁹ has the same $\sqrt{1-k}$ form, with $k = v^2/c^2$. Since velocity is distance per unit time, v^2/c^2 is the square of a ratio of two lengths, with the shared time unit canceling.

System properties:

	System 1 (S_1)	System 2 (S_2)
m (kg)	1.00000e30	1.00000e24
r (m)	1.00000e8	1.00000e8

Calculate DTD for each System:

$$\begin{aligned}
 DTD &= \sqrt{k} \quad \text{where} \quad k = m/(rD_{\text{crit}}) \\
 k_1 &= \frac{1.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(1.00000e8 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 1.48523e-5 \\
 DTD_1 &= \sqrt{1.48523e-5} = 3.85387e-3 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{1.00000e24 \text{ kg}}{(1.00000e8 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 1.48523e-11 \\
 DTD_2 &= \sqrt{1.48523e-11} = 3.85387e-6 \\
 \frac{DTD_1}{DTD_2} &= \frac{3.85387e-3}{3.85387e-6} = 1.00000e3 \\
 \frac{DTD_2}{DTD_1} &= \frac{3.85387e-6}{3.85387e-3} = 1.00000e-3
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate the GTD ratio from DTD:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= \frac{\sqrt{1-DTD_1^2}}{\sqrt{1-DTD_2^2}} = \frac{\sqrt{1-(3.85387e-3)^2}}{\sqrt{1-(3.85387e-6)^2}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{1-1.48523e-5}}{\sqrt{1-1.48523e-11}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{9.999851477e-1}}{\sqrt{9.999999999851477e-1}} \\
 &= \frac{9.9999257381e-1}{9.999999999257381e-1} = 9.9999257381e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.42619e-6
 \end{aligned}$$

Verify by calculating the GTD from the Schwarzschild Radius Ratio: Schwarzschild radii:

$$\begin{aligned}
 r_{s1} &= \frac{2Gm_1}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e30 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523e3 \text{ m} \\
 r_{s2} &= \frac{2Gm_2}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e24 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523e-3 \text{ m}
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate k values from the r_s/r ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 k_1 &= \frac{r_{s1}}{r_1} = \frac{1.48523e3 \text{ m}}{1.00000e8 \text{ m}} = 1.48523e-5 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{r_{s2}}{r_2} = \frac{1.48523e-3 \text{ m}}{1.00000e8 \text{ m}} = 1.48523e-11
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate GTD via Schwarzschild radius ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 GTD_{s1} &= \sqrt{1-k_1} = \sqrt{9.999851477e-1} = 9.9999257381e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.42619e-6 \\
 GTD_{s2} &= \sqrt{1-k_2} = \sqrt{9.999999999851477e-1} \\
 &= 9.999999999257384e-1 = 1 - 7.42616e-12 \\
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= \frac{9.9999257381e-1}{9.999999999257384e-1} \\
 &= 9.9999257382e-1 = 1 - 7.42618e-6
 \end{aligned}$$

Time-dilation ratio between System 1 and System 2, computed two ways:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= 1 - 7.42618e-6 \quad (\text{via } r_s) \\
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= 1 - 7.42619e-6 \quad (\text{via } D_{\text{crit}})
 \end{aligned}$$

4.4 Case 4: ($\rho_1 = \rho_2$)

When the two systems share the same density, $m \propto r^3$, so $m_1/m_2 = (r_1/r_2)^3$.

System properties:

	System 1 (S_1)	System 2 (S_2)
m (kg)	1.00000e30	1.00000e27
r (m)	1.00000e8	1.00000e7

Calculate DTD for each System:

$$\begin{aligned}
 DTD &= \sqrt{k} \quad \text{where} \quad k = m/(rD_{\text{crit}}) \\
 k_1 &= \frac{1.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(1.00000e8 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 1.48523e-5 \\
 DTD_1 &= \sqrt{1.48523e-5} = 3.85387e-3 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{1.00000e27 \text{ kg}}{(1.00000e7 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 1.48523e-7 \\
 DTD_2 &= \sqrt{1.48523e-7} = 3.85387e-4 \\
 \frac{DTD_1}{DTD_2} &= \frac{3.85387e-3}{3.85387e-4} = 1.00000e1 \\
 \frac{DTD_2}{DTD_1} &= \frac{3.85387e-4}{3.85387e-3} = 1.00000e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate the GTD ratio from DTD:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= \frac{\sqrt{1-DTD_1^2}}{\sqrt{1-DTD_2^2}} = \frac{\sqrt{1-(3.85387e-3)^2}}{\sqrt{1-(3.85387e-4)^2}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{1-1.48523e-5}}{\sqrt{1-1.48523e-7}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{9.999851477e-1}}{\sqrt{9.99999851477e-1}} \\
 &= \frac{9.9999257381e-1}{9.99999257383e-1} = 9.9999264807e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.35193e-6
 \end{aligned}$$

Verify by calculating the GTD from the Schwarzschild Radius Ratio: Schwarzschild radii:

$$\begin{aligned}
 r_{s1} &= \frac{2Gm_1}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e30 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523e3 \text{ m} \\
 r_{s2} &= \frac{2Gm_2}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e27 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523 \text{ m}
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate k values from the r_s/r ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 k_1 &= \frac{r_{s1}}{r_1} = \frac{1.48523e3 \text{ m}}{1.00000e8 \text{ m}} = 1.48523e-5 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{r_{s2}}{r_2} = \frac{1.48523 \text{ m}}{1.00000e7 \text{ m}} = 1.48523e-7
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate GTD via Schwarzschild radius ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 GTD_{s1} &= \sqrt{1-k_1} = \sqrt{9.999851477e-1} = 9.9999257381e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.42619e-6 \\
 GTD_{s2} &= \sqrt{1-k_2} = \sqrt{9.99999851477e-1} = 9.99999257384e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.42616e-8 \\
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= \frac{9.9999257381e-1}{9.99999257384e-1} \\
 &= 9.9999264807e-1 = 1 - 7.35193e-6
 \end{aligned}$$

Time-dilation ratio between System 1 and System 2, computed two ways:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= 1 - 7.35193e-6 \quad (\text{via } r_s) \\
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= 1 - 7.35193e-6 \quad (\text{via } D_{\text{crit}})
 \end{aligned}$$

4.7 Case 7: (General, unconstrained)

When no constraint is applied between the systems, both mass and radius must be specified independently for each system.

System properties:

	System 1 (S_1)	System 2 (S_2)
m (kg)	1.00000e20	1.00000e30
r (m)	2.00000e-7	1.00000e7

Calculate DTD for each System:

$$\begin{aligned}
 DTD &= \sqrt{k} \quad \text{where} \quad k = m/(rD_{\text{crit}}) \\
 k_1 &= \frac{1.00000e20 \text{ kg}}{(2.00000e-7 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 7.42617e-1 \\
 DTD_1 &= \sqrt{7.42617e-1} = 8.61752e-1 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{1.00000e30 \text{ kg}}{(1.00000e7 \text{ m})(6.73295e26 \text{ kg/m})} = 1.48523e-4 \\
 DTD_2 &= \sqrt{1.48523e-4} = 1.21870e-2 \\
 \frac{DTD_1}{DTD_2} &= \frac{8.61752e-1}{1.21870e-2} = 7.07107e1
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate the GTD ratio from DTD:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= \frac{\sqrt{1 - DTD_1^2}}{\sqrt{1 - DTD_2^2}} = \frac{\sqrt{1 - (8.61752e-1)^2}}{\sqrt{1 - (1.21870e-2)^2}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{1 - 7.42617e-1}}{\sqrt{1 - 1.48523e-4}} \\
 &= \frac{\sqrt{2.57383e-1}}{\sqrt{9.99851477e-1}} \\
 &= \frac{5.07330e-1}{9.999257356e-1} = 5.07367e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 4.92633e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Verify by calculating the GTD from the Schwarzschild Radius Ratio:
Schwarzschild radii:

$$\begin{aligned}
 r_{s1} &= \frac{2Gm_1}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e20 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523e-7 \text{ m} \\
 r_{s2} &= \frac{2Gm_2}{c^2} = \frac{2(6.67430e-11 \text{ m}^3 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ s}^{-2})(1.00000e30 \text{ kg})}{(2.99792e8 \text{ m s}^{-1})^2} \\
 &= 1.48523e3 \text{ m}
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate k values from the r_s/r ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 k_1 &= \frac{r_{s1}}{r_1} = \frac{1.48523e-7 \text{ m}}{2.00000e-7 \text{ m}} = 7.42616e-1 \\
 k_2 &= \frac{r_{s2}}{r_2} = \frac{1.48523e3 \text{ m}}{1.00000e7 \text{ m}} = 1.48523e-4
 \end{aligned}$$

Calculate GTD via Schwarzschild radius ratio:

$$\begin{aligned}
 GTD_{s1} &= \sqrt{1 - k_1} = \sqrt{2.57384e-1} = 5.07330e-1 = 1 - 4.92670e-1 \\
 GTD_{s2} &= \sqrt{1 - k_2} = \sqrt{9.99851477e-1} = 9.999257356e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 7.42644e-5 \\
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= \frac{5.07330e-1}{9.999257356e-1} = 5.07368e-1 \\
 &= 1 - 4.92632e-1
 \end{aligned}$$

Time-dilation ratio between System 1 and System 2, computed two ways:

$$\begin{aligned}
 \frac{GTD_{s1}}{GTD_{s2}} &= 1 - 4.92632e-1 \quad (\text{via } r_s) \\
 \frac{GTD_{d1}}{GTD_{d2}} &= 1 - 4.92633e-1 \quad (\text{via } D_{\text{crit}})
 \end{aligned}$$

5 Analysis

The experiment behaved exactly as the framework predicts. That the results lined up as cleanly as they did was not guaranteed in advance, but in retrospect it is unsurprising: the mathematics is already present in general relativity, and the framework simply reads it in the two-system, scale-free form.

5.1 Scale preference and the relative nature of relativity

General and special relativity, as ordinarily presented, carry a strong *scale preference*: a view of the universe centered on the human scale. We have confronted and largely accepted this problem for space, but we have never confronted it for time. Time continues to be treated as absolute — our time taken as the preferred clock, everything else measured relative to it — even though time is governed by a theory named *relativity*. The deeper problem is that relativity is not generally understood to be relative; consensus does not clearly assert the relative nature of relativity, even where individuals understand it. This is the sense of the paper's title: relativity is always relative. Everything observable is relative; there is nothing one can observe that is not.

5.2 The fallacy of the negligible

A recurring error underlies the scale-preferential habit. We look at a quantity that falls off toward infinity, becoming very small, and judge that by our own frame it is too small to matter. This is a sound *practical* judgment about relevance to our frame of reference, but it is not a *mathematical* result, and it does not make our frame preferential. The error surfaces in a family of interchangeable phrases — negligible, almost nothing, infinitesimal, practically nonexistent, flat spacetime, time stoppage, time stops — all amounting to the same move. Many are used loosely; in particular, there are no genuine *divergences* here, and the term is frequently not used in its proper sense.

5.3 Flat spacetime is asymptotic

Near our own scale, presuming that we calculate time dilation against flat spacetime causes little trouble. But flat spacetime is never actually reached. For any flat spacetime one can construct, there is an infinity of flatter spacetime beyond it; no matter how flat a spacetime appears, there is always flatter. Crucially, the picture is the same at every scale of flatness: standing at any such scale, an observer would see the surroundings as just as curved as they appear to us locally. One never obtains a qualitatively different picture at that scale. It is always the same at the observer's scale — and even as an observer grows, it remains the same at their *current* scale, which correctly implies that it differs between their prior scale and their current one.

5.4 Scale as lived experience

We are among the rare things that occupy different scales over a lifetime. As children, adults seemed very large; as adults, children seem very small — a change of scale perspective. We begin with small, high voices that deepen; we become large beings quite different from the children we were, altering both the spatial and

the temporal experience of the whole body. Yet a body's cells do not experience time differently from another body's cells: they are of roughly the same constituency, size, and density. A brain may scale larger or smaller, but the pace of time within its cells and nerves stays consistent — essential for temporal measurement. On average, we do not metabolize as fast as a smaller organism, nor as slowly as a larger one.

5.5 No system without mass and radius

The framework implies that there can be no system without mass and radius, at least some of each. Two conventional objects are drawn into question by this: the photon and the singularity. We hold no stake in either and no reluctance to challenge either if it does not hold up; the point is that both imply an unbounded scale that other views of the cosmos do not necessarily support. The same reasoning bears on the interpretation of the cosmic microwave background, which is sometimes offered — though rarely admitted outright — as evidence for a limit to scale. Such a limit is not congruent with an inertia-based theory, which requires that everything in a system possess some mass and radius. To posit anything with neither is itself a scale-preferential move.

5.6 General relativity as the governing factor

The framework indicates that general relativity is the real governing factor, and that it does so without an apparatus of many distinct field models. (Charge-based models have not been examined here.) Notably, Kerr and ordinary black holes are described equally well by the Schwarzschild metric expanded to three dimensions — the natural setting for an inertial model of this kind.

5.7 Redshift as inertial time dilation

A clear expectation follows: substantial redshift when viewing distant objects that are not themselves deep gravitational wells. Such objects may contain deep wells without constituting one, and ordinary intuition says they should therefore not redshift. But relative to us they carry significant inertial time dilation — the broader package of relative time dilation — and so exhibit that slower pace of time. This is, in the end, purely gravitational: general relativity already accounts for the broad, low-density black holes at the centers of galaxies, up to and including the entire observable universe. Redshift then carries a clean, usable meaning: it reports the spatial distribution of mass. The measurement is two-dimensional — mass over mean radius for the circle of sky under view. For a galactic cluster, one measures the cluster; for the region including the cluster, one includes all of it. Because $m/\bar{r}$ yields only the average within that sphere, finer granularity is obtained with a smaller sample. General relativity provides an adequate account of the *entirety* of the redshift, from which the spatial distribution of mass can be read directly and validated; speed of expansion and system age are, by contrast, not meaningful quantities in this account. The essential test is narrow: does general relativity predict what we observe, and does it predict more or less than we observe? It predicts less, leaving a genuine remainder to be explained; were it to predict more than we see, the framework itself would be in trouble, and that possibility is

left open rather than assumed away. These are accessible validations, achievable with well-characterized, nearby systems such as Andromeda.

5.8 Unification of general and special relativity through inertia

This is a genuine unification of general and special relativity, developed in the preceding papers and further validated here: general relativity is carried by rotational inertia (the moment of inertia), special relativity by ordinary linear inertia (mass), and general relativity is, in this reading, born of the moment of inertia. The premise that yields this can be stated and tested directly: presume that the inertia of any object or system — about a chosen axis, or along a chosen linear dimension — *is* the pace of time for that whole system, and follow the consequences. Special and general relativity emerge necessarily, which makes it nearly inconceivable that the premise is false. The definition of inertia supports it: inertia, linear or rotational, is the property that translates an applied force into the resulting change in motion, and any two systems with the same moment of inertia, under the same applied force, undergo the same temporal effect regardless of how each attained it. In this sense the moment of inertia is literally system time; taken with inertia's additive, conservational nature, it yields a clean, logical model of causality. None of this changes what we observe or how we perceive it. It is a different frame of observation — the system frame. We ordinarily adopt a system frame and presume it to be the universal frame; it is not. Whether one calls the effect "time dilation" or "time scale," it is the same thing, and it is indistinguishable in Einstein's sense — but no citation is required, because this is general relativity. To attack it is to attack general relativity.

5.9 Vision and color as a redshift mechanism

A striking consequence is that human vision very likely uses a redshift mechanism to perceive color; if it does not, that would point to a serious problem with the framework, so it is a real test. For such a mechanism the sensing element must sit at a consistent position relative to the incoming light, and the chromophores do: mounted to the retina, always perpendicular to the incoming light, each receives light at a consistent angle. The cone-shaped chromophore bends at its middle when struck by a particular wavelength; bending in the right direction covers its photosensitive portion and halts the reaction, after which it relaxes back to a straight structure, ready to be excited again. Three copies of the same chromophore across three cone sizes each shield the light's angle just enough to sample a slightly different range of inertial density, and from the three cones together the system triangulates where the incoming signal falls within that range. What the eye is really reading is mass over radius about the axis of observation: taking a chromophore as it faces the plane perpendicular to the incoming light and computing its mass over mean radius yields a value on the order of 10^{-43} in the corresponding units. Denser systems, with more mass concentrated in a smaller region, have a smaller moment of inertia and therefore a faster pace of time; as rough magnitudes, white and yellow sit near 10^{-43} , red near

10^{-43} , and blue near 10^{-44} , with infrared beyond the red and ultraviolet beyond the blue. This appears to hold whether the colorant is solid, liquid, or gas.

Chemistry explains these colors by electron transitions, and for larger coloring molecules that description matches the behavior; but the noble gases have no good electron-based explanation and are regarded as an anomaly. From the inertial-density view there is no anomaly: inertial density rises as inertia increases over the same volume, up to the DeGerlia Threshold $D_{\text{crit}} = 6.73295\text{e}26\text{kg/m}$, and the radius at which electrons orbit the nucleus bears materially on the moment of inertia — enough to shift the time dilation between observing and observed systems. Neon, for instance, becomes bluer when compressed and redder when the pressure is reduced. The same reasoning covers small-particle systems in the ultraviolet that trickle into the visible, such as water or the daytime blue sky. The decisive test would be predicting a compound's optical resonance from geometry alone: taking water, present as H_2O , H_3O^+ , and OH^- , one computes each form's mass-to-radius ratio about each of its three axes to obtain a range of resonance per axis, and weighting by proportion yields a representative peak for each three-dimensional orientation. This opens the prospect of engineering compounds to meet a target absorption pattern, made uniform across viewing axes or deliberately non-uniform.

5.10 Assessment of the framework

The framework proved useful and exhibited every characteristic expected of it. The salient finding concerns the scale-dilation term: either scale dilation has been rendered entirely out of gravitational time dilation, or — more likely — it has been interpreted away in a human-centric manner until it carries no meaning. As anticipated, the normalization that drives the value into $[0, 1]$ carries a factor that, if presumed negligible, is simply lost, and it should never be presumed negligible with respect to the functioning of the system at hand. The framework does make the time-dilation changes clear and intuitive: in the classical worked example the scale factor came out to 2, exactly as expected — a purely spatial effect, with time dilation negligible. The real take-away concerns DTD versus GTD. DTD, $\sqrt{k}$, is a faithful representation of time dilation that the GTD form $\sqrt{1-k}$ does not fully expose; removing the “1–” leaves a remarkably clean and complete framework, of which GTD gives only a shadow. The two carry the same information — but one cannot fully map back to the original systems from either quantity alone without the actual real-world parameters of at least one system.

6 Conclusions

The DeGerlia time dilation framework introduces no new physics. It is a reframing of general relativity, mathematically equivalent to the standard gravitational time-dilation calculation and reproducing it across every case examined.

The gravitational time-dilation formula is already a two-system relation. The scale factor $k = r_s/r$ is a ratio of two radii — a system's radius and the Schwarzschild radius of its own mass — so the familiar single-system calculation is a two-system compar-

ison in which the second system has been fixed and left unstated. Across seven cases spanning the classical and relativistic regimes, computing the relative time dilation from the systems' DeGerlia inertial density reproduces the standard Schwarzschild result exactly, to the precision permitted by G . The second system is therefore not an idealization to be discarded; it contributes to the result, and its contribution is exact.

This selects a privileged inertial frame of reference, one tied to a particular scale. Where only that scale is in play, the single-system framing gives good results. The error is in presuming it extends — that a quantity negligible at one scale is negligible for the system itself or at every scale. This error is not insignificant, and it grows without exception toward stronger fields: the neglected contribution of the second system is $1 - \sqrt{1-k}$, which increases monotonically with $k = D/D_{\text{crit}}$. Recognizing time dilation as the inherently two-system quantity it already is removes that presumption.

The same structure applies to gravitational collapse. The black-hole condition is $m/r = D_{\text{crit}} = 6.73295\text{e}26\text{kg/m}$ — equivalently, a radius equal to the Schwarzschild radius of the mass. This is a single relation between two free quantities: for any mass there is a radius that satisfies it, and for any radius a mass. Neither is bounded, and no value of either is excluded.

More broadly, the framework makes explicit that relativity is relative. There is no privileged frame or scale from which time is measured absolutely: any observer's account of the flow of time differs from another's, yet no two accounts describe different systems — they describe the same systems, at the same events, observed from different scales.

Flat spacetime is likewise asymptotic; it is never reached. For any spacetime one constructs there is a flatter one, and at every scale of flatness the surroundings appear as curved as ours do to us locally — the picture is identical at every observer's scale. The single-system habit treats an unreachable limit as an attained background; the two-system formulation does not.

The same inertial reading unifies the two relativities. General relativity is carried by rotational inertia and special relativity by linear inertia, with the moment of inertia serving as system time: two systems of equal moment of inertia under equal applied force undergo the same temporal effect, however each attained it. As with the rest of the framework, this follows directly from general relativity, so to contest it is to contest general relativity.

Time dilation is a relative comparison between two systems, already present in the standard formula.

7 Hypotheses of Explanation

These are items whose explanation we understand and hold to be right. We do not label them *theory* beyond what is warranted — but that restraint is the strength of a hypothesis of explanation, not a retreat from the result. That each was *predicted* by the framework already makes the case strong; what remains genuinely open is only the *meaning* one attaches to some of them. We have not exhaustively demonstrated, numerically and on paper, that every one is consistent in every case with the predictions of general and special relativity — but nothing here requires new observations. No new tests need be run; the observations would

not change. The only open question is whether it adds up under this understanding, and it does.

The explanations put forward, each following from the framework and each already consistent with what we observe:

1. *Redshift is inertial time dilation, not cosmic expansion.* Distant systems that are not themselves deep gravitational wells still carry significant inertial time dilation relative to us and therefore redshift. General relativity accounts for the entirety of the effect, and the redshift then reads directly as the spatial distribution of mass, $m/\bar{r}$ over the field of view — a clean and validatable quantity, where the age of the universe and the speed of expansion are not.
2. *Human color vision is a redshift mechanism.* The eye reads mass over radius about the axis of observation. The chromophores' fixed perpendicular mounting to the retina, the cone-size triad, and the inertial-density-to-color mapping all follow from this, and it is a real, falsifiable test of the framework.
3. *A compound's optical resonance is predictable from its geometry.* Mass-to-radius ratios about a molecule's three axes give its resonance ranges and peaks, including the noble-gas behavior — neon bluer under compression, redder under reduced pressure — that electron-transition accounts treat as anomalous.

The value of a hypothesis of explanation is its flexibility: it sets out the account without the overreach of asserting settled theory, and it stays open to test rather than pretending to be closed. Had cosmic expansion been held to that same standard — offered as a hypothesis rather than asserted as established — it would not now require the repeated revisions it does.

Because the underlying relationship is simultaneously one of inertia and density, the inertia component imparts dimensionality to time. Consequently, although the present exploration is restricted to uniform spherical systems, the framework extends to asymmetrical systems, including large low-density black holes, Kerr black holes⁴, and the observable universe.

By contrast, the unification through inertia and the conclusions above are held to a firmer standard than hypothesis: they follow directly from general relativity and are not offered tentatively.

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Conflicts of Interest

The author declares no competing interests.

Data Availability

The complete source materials for this paper, including all $\text{\LaTeX}$ source files, derivation documents, and revision history, are publicly available at: https://github.com/denverdata/academic_InertialRelativity_STE_cases.

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